

Who Can Get Away with Raising Prices?

Demand and Elasticity

ECON 201: Principles of Microeconomics
Lecture 7

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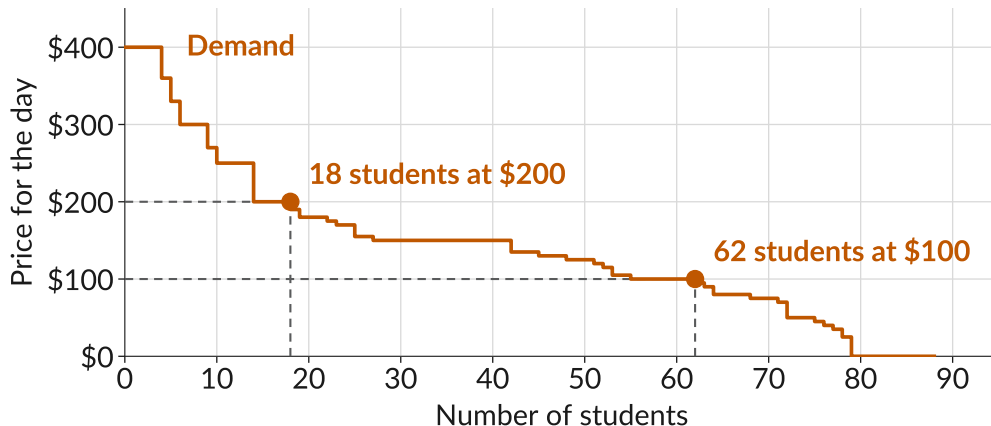
Last Class: The Cost Side

$$\text{Profit} = \underbrace{P \times Q}_{\text{revenue}} - \underbrace{C(Q)}_{\text{cost}}$$

- Last class we focused on the cost side, $C(Q)$.
- Today we focus on revenue, $P \times Q$, which depends on the **demand curve**.
- Remember the **trade-off**: if firm set's higher price, it will loose some consumers. How many? That depends on the demand curve.

How Much Would You Pay?

In Lecture 3, I asked for the most you would pay for a day at a **Dodgers** game. What you gave me was your **willingness to pay (WTP)**, and we can use it to construct a demand curve.



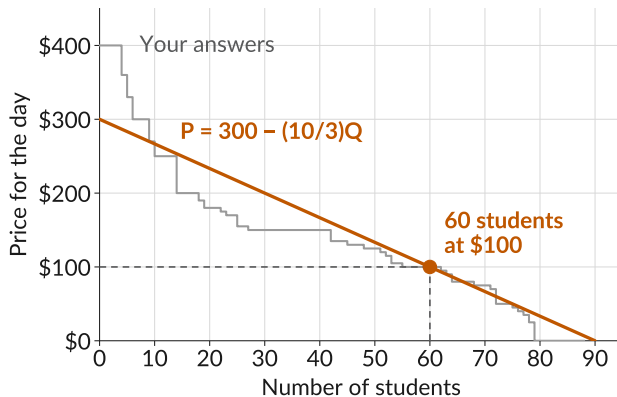
Willingness to Pay

- **Willingness to pay (WTP)** is an indicator of how much a person values a good, measured by the maximum amount they would pay to acquire a unit of the good.
- You will go to the game if the price for the day is less than or equal to your WTP.
- At any price, demand is the number of students whose willingness to pay is at least that price.
- At \$200, 18 of you have a WTP of \$200 or more, so demand is 18. At \$100, demand is 62.

The Demand Curve for a Dodgers Game

Linearizing your answers gives this demand curve:

$$P = 300 - \frac{10}{3} Q \quad \Rightarrow \quad Q = 90 - 0.3 P$$



How Much Does Demand Respond?

- Sellers setting ticket prices, and economists and policymakers setting policy, often want to know how a change in price will change the quantity people buy.
- Your demand curve is $Q = 90 - 0.3 P$. If the price rises by \$10, from \$100 to \$110, demand falls by 3 students.
 - When $P = 100$, $Q = 90 - 0.3 \times 100 = 60$.
 - When $P = 110$, $Q = 90 - 0.3 \times 110 = 57$.
- Often it is more useful to measure the change in percentage terms: if the price rises by 1%, by what percentage does the quantity fall?
- This standard measure is called the **price elasticity of demand**.

Price Elasticity of Demand

The **price elasticity of demand** is the percentage change in demand that would occur in response to a 1% increase in price:

$$\varepsilon = - \frac{\% \text{ change in demand}}{\% \text{ change in price}}$$

- Quantity falls when price increases, so the minus sign ensures that we get a positive number.
- Demand is **elastic** if ε is greater than 1, and **inelastic** if less than 1.

Elasticity of Demand for a Dodgers Game

When the price rises from \$100 to \$110, demand falls from 60 to 57 students.

$$\% \text{ change in price} = \frac{110 - 100}{100} \times 100 = 10\%$$

$$\% \text{ change in demand} = \frac{57 - 60}{60} \times 100 = -5\%$$

$$\epsilon = -\frac{-5}{10} = 0.5$$

- At \$100, a 1% increase in the price reduces the number of you who would go by 0.5%, so demand is inelastic.

Worksheet, Activity 1

The demand curve is given by $Q = 90 - 0.3P$. Find the elasticity of demand for each \$10 price rise below. At which prices is demand elastic?

$$\% \text{ change} = \frac{\text{new} - \text{old}}{\text{old}} \times 100$$

$$\varepsilon = -\frac{\% \text{ change in } Q}{\% \text{ change in } P}$$

P rises from	Q falls from	% change in P	% change in Q	Elasticity, ε
\$50 to \$60				
\$100 to \$110				
\$200 to \$210				

Four Ways to Write the Elasticity

When price changes by ΔP and demand by ΔQ :

	Using	Elasticity
1	Percentage changes	$\varepsilon = -\frac{\% \text{ change in } Q}{\% \text{ change in } P}$
2	Proportional changes	$\varepsilon = -\frac{\Delta Q/Q}{\Delta P/P}$
3	The fraction simplified	$\varepsilon = -\frac{P}{Q} \times \frac{\Delta Q}{\Delta P}$
4	The slope of the demand curve, $\Delta P/\Delta Q$	$\varepsilon = -\frac{P}{Q} \times \frac{1}{\text{slope}}$

Worksheet, Activity 2

Use formula 3 to find the elasticity at the same three prices. Do you get the same answers as in Activity 1?

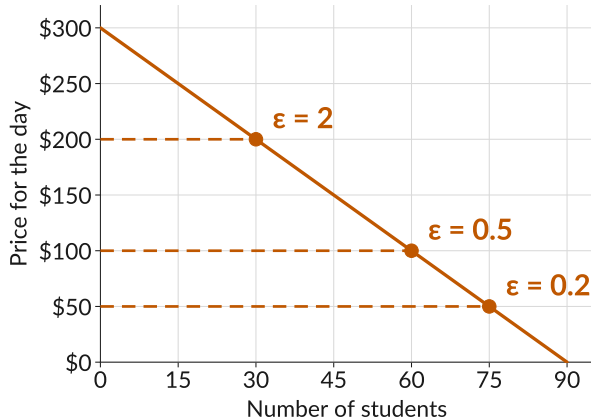
$$Q = 90 - 0.3 P \qquad \varepsilon = -\frac{P}{Q} \times \frac{\Delta Q}{\Delta P}$$

Here, $\Delta Q/\Delta P = -0.3$: every \$1 rise in price changes demand by -0.3 .

Price, P	\$50	\$100	\$200
Demand, Q	75	60	30
Elasticity, ε			

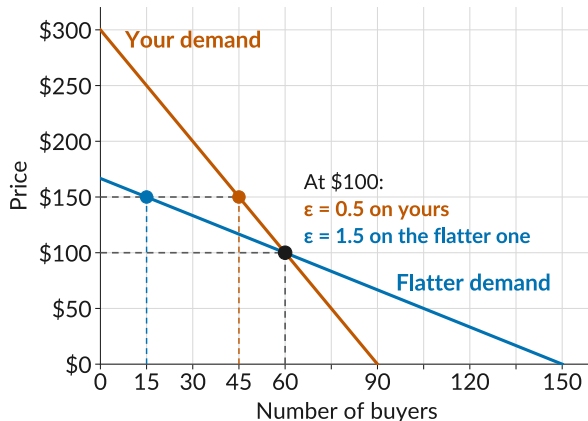
Elasticity Along the Demand Curve

- As we move down a straight demand curve, the price falls and the quantity rises, so the elasticity falls.
- At a high price, few people still buy. Losing a few more is a large share of the buyers, so demand is elastic.
- At a low price, many people buy. Losing the same few is a small share of them, so demand is inelastic.



Flat and Steep Demand Curves

- Both curves pass through the same point: 60 buyers at \$100.
- Raise the price to \$150. On your curve, buyers fall to 45. On the flatter curve, they fall to 15.
- So at \$100, demand is more elastic on the flatter curve: $\epsilon = 1.5$, against 0.5 on yours.



Why Measure How Buyers Respond?

Anyone who sets a price needs to know how buyers will respond to it.

- A firm wants to know whether a higher price brings in more revenue or less.
- A city wants to know whether a higher bus fare raises money or empties the buses.
- A government wants to know how much less people will buy of a good it taxes.

But why measure how buyers respond in **percentage changes**?

So we can compare goods with very different prices and units, like cars and gasoline.

Why Percentage Changes?

Suppose we want to know who responds more to price changes: people buying cars or people buying gasoline.

- A car costs tens of thousands of dollars, and gasoline costs a few dollars a gallon. A \$1 price rise is nothing for a car and a big jump for gasoline.
- Car sales are counted in cars and gasoline in gallons, so “units lost for each \$1 rise” cannot be compared either.
- Percentage changes remove both problems: a 10% price rise is the same size of change for a car and for a gallon of gas.
- So we compare the percentage fall in quantity for a 1% rise in price. That is the elasticity.

Why Elasticity Differs Between Goods

Demand is more elastic when buyers can easily switch or buy less:

Reason	More elastic	Less elastic
Close substitutes	Coffee at Starbucks	Electricity
Luxury, not necessity	Concert tickets	A doctor's visit
Narrowly defined market	Vanilla ice cream	Food
More time to adjust	Gas over five years	Gas this week
Big share of spending	A new car	Salt

Real-World Elasticities: Uber

Uber raises prices at busy times, and the app rounds the surge multiplier to one decimal.

- A surge of 1.249 shows as 1.2x, and 1.251 shows as 1.3x. Riders on each side face the same conditions, but one group pays 8.3% more.
- At that cutoff, ride requests are about 3% lower. What is the elasticity?

$$\varepsilon = -\frac{-3}{8.3} \approx 0.36$$

Across almost 50 million sessions, most estimates are between 0.4 and 0.6 (Cohen et al., 2016).

Real-World Elasticities: Philadelphia's Soda Tax

In 2017, Philadelphia taxed sweetened drinks 1.5 cents per ounce, and prices at stores in the city rose by 34%.

- Sales at stores in the city fell by 46%, so demand there was elastic:
 $\varepsilon = 46/34 \approx 1.35$.
- Many shoppers drove to stores just outside the city. Counting those stores, purchases fell by only 22%, so $\varepsilon = 22/34 \approx 0.65$.
- Stores just outside the city are close substitutes, so demand at city stores is more elastic than demand for soda overall.
- Both numbers matter for policy: the city's tax revenue depends on the 1.35, and how much less soda people drink depends on the 0.65 (Seiler, Tuchman, and Yao, 2021).

Real-World Elasticities: Everyday Foods

Average elasticities from 160 US studies (Andreyyeva, Long, and Brownell, 2010):

Food or drink	Elasticity
Meals away from home	0.81
Soft drinks	0.79
Fruit	0.70
Milk	0.59
Eggs	0.27

Every food here is inelastic. Meals out respond most, because cooking at home is a close substitute. Eggs respond least: there is no good substitute at breakfast.

Quiz 3

- Quiz 3 is Monday, September 21, and covers Lectures 5 to 7.
- Go through all the slides and work through worksheets and the practice problems before the quiz.

Sources

- Cohen, Hahn, Hall, Levitt, and Metcalfe (2016), “Using Big Data to Estimate Consumer Surplus: The Case of Uber,” NBER Working Paper 22627.
- Seiler, Tuchman, and Yao (2021), “The Impact of Soda Taxes: Pass-Through, Tax Avoidance, and Nutritional Effects,” *Journal of Marketing Research* 58(1).
- Andreyeva, Long, and Brownell (2010), “The Impact of Food Prices on Consumption: A Systematic Review of Research on the Price Elasticity of Demand for Food,” *American Journal of Public Health* 100(2).